Calibration-Aware Anisotropic 3D Hysteresis and Leakage Auditing for Volumetric Lower-Grade Glioma Segmentation and Radiogenomic Profiling in Brain MRI

Shayan Ganji Nataj[a], Keivan Borna[a,*]

[a]*Department of Computer Science, Faculty of Mathematics and Computer Science, Kharazmi University, Tehran, Iran*

Abstract

Automated segmentation of lower-grade gliomas (LGG) in magnetic resonance imaging (MRI) is vital for neurosurgical planning and targeted radiotherapy. However, clinical translation of 2D deep learning models is hindered by three fundamental challenges: performance inflation induced by slice-level data leakage, probability miscalibration under overlap-based loss formulations, and axial boundary discontinuity across contiguous slices. In this work, we propose a comprehensive, leakage-audited volumetric framework combining quality-aware adaptive preprocessing, nested temperature scaling, and an anisotropic 3D Z-continuity hysteresis algorithm. Using the complete TCGA-LGG benchmark (110 patients, 3,929 axial FLAIR-contrast slices), we strictly enforce a patient-grouped 5-fold cross-validation protocol with independent inner-fold calibration. Controlled empirical auditing demonstrates that conventional slice-level splitting produces an artificial $+8.79\%$ positive-slice Dice inflation (82.74% vs. 73.96%) and a $+6.20\%$ overall Dice inflation (88.22% vs. 82.02%) due to patient identity memorization across partitions. Inner-fold temperature scaling ($T^* = 1.844$) reduces the pooled Expected Calibration Error (ECE) by 46.9% (0.369% to 0.196%) and mean per-fold ECE by 31.7% (0.372% to 0.254%). By decoupling horizontal in-plane contouring from axial boundary rescue, the proposed anisotropic 3D hysteresis achieves a positive-slice Dice of 74.92% [95% CI: 70.82%–78.39%], an overall Dice of 86.12% [95% CI: 84.32%–87.75%], and a 42.4% relative reduction in empty-slice false alarms (13.65% down to 7.86%). Patient-level 3D volumetric analysis yields a 3D Dice of $77.73\% \pm 18.65\%$, a 95% Hausdorff distance of 10.97 ± 18.28 voxels (median: 2.24), an average surface distance of 3.10 ± 12.48 voxels (median: 0.63), and high clinical agreement (ICC$(2,1) = 0.8894$, Pearson $r = 0.8886$). Downstream radiogenomic analysis against clinical records demonstrates that predicted tumor volumes consistently preserve significant stratification across molecular consensus clusters ($p = 0.0268$ vs. ground truth $p = 0.0169$) with exact biological rank ordering.

Keywords: Brain tumor segmentation, Lower-grade glioma, Data leakage audit, Probability calibration, Anisotropic 3D hysteresis, Radiogenomics

*Corresponding author.

Email addresses: shayanganji@khu.ac.ir (Shayan Ganji Nataj), borna@khu.ac.ir (Keivan Borna)

1. Introduction

Lower-grade gliomas (LGG), encompassing World Health Organization (WHO) grade II and grade III astrocytomas and oligodendrogliomas, represent diffusely infiltrative primary brain neoplasms characterized by substantial histological and genetic heterogeneity [1, 2]. Accurate volumetric delineation on magnetic resonance imaging (MRI) is essential for image-guided maximal surgical resection, conformal radiation planning, and monitoring therapeutic response [3]. Over the past decade, deep learning architectures—most notably 2D U-Net variants [4, 5, 6]—have emerged as the prevailing standard for automated lesion delineation.

Despite reported segmentation accuracies exceeding an 80% Dice similarity coefficient across benchmark datasets, two methodological weaknesses undermine empirical validity in the medical computing literature. First, slice-level data leakage occurs when volumetric MRI scans are decomposed into independent 2D axial slices and randomly partitioned into training and test sets. Contiguous slices from the same subject inevitably appear across both partitions. Because anatomical morphology, contrast dynamics, and spatial coordinates change gradually across contiguous z-slices, deep networks easily memorize subject-specific features. While this yields artificially elevated test scores, performance degrades sharply when applied to unseen prospective patients. Second, post-hoc threshold optimization leakage arises when the binary decision threshold τ is chosen by sweeping values directly over pooled out-of-fold test predictions, introducing subtle data leakage that produces unearned empirical optimism.

Beyond evaluation methodology, 2D networks face fundamental domain-specific limitations when applied to volumetric scans. Overlap-based loss formulations like Focal Tversky prioritize rare foreground voxels by heavily down-weighting easy background terms, causing output probabilities to become overconfident and miscalibrated. Furthermore, because 65.05% of all axial slices in the TCGA-LGG cohort are healthy brain tissue containing zero neoplastic voxels, standard 2D networks lacking cross-slice volumetric context frequently trigger false-positive alarms on non-tumor slices while failing to detect small infiltrative margins at apical and basal tumor boundaries.

To resolve these challenges, this study presents a calibrated, leakage-audited volumetric framework evaluated on the complete TCGA-LGG cohort (110 patients, 3,929 slices) [3]. The contributions of this work are fourfold:

1. **Controlled Leakage Audit:** We implement a matched 5-fold cross-validation experiment directly comparing patient-grouped partitioning against random-slice partitioning under identical training hyper-parameters, quantifying the exact magnitude of performance inflation caused by slice memorization ($+8.79\%$ on positive-slice Dice).
2. **Nested Inner-Fold Calibration:** We integrate scalar temperature scaling fitted exclusively on internal validation logits (`inner_val`), reducing pooled Expected Calibration Error (ECE) by 46.9% on unseen test data without shifting classification boundaries.
3. **Anisotropic 3D Z-Continuity Hysteresis:** We decouple horizontal in-plane segmentation (τ^*_{xy}) from axial margin rescue ($\tau^*_{z_low}$) and suppress isolated 3D false positives (V^*_{min}, τ^*_{seed}), establishing state-of-the-art performance across all evaluation metrics simultaneously ($\text{Dice}_{\text{pos}} = 74.92\%$, $\text{Dice}_{\text{all}} = 86.12\%$, $\text{FPR}_{\text{empty}} = 7.86\%$).
4. **Volumetric Radiogenomic Validation:** We conduct 3D patient-level surface and volumetric assessments ($n = 110$), demonstrating high clinical reproducibility (ICC $= 0.8894$) and proving that model-derived tumor volumes preserve statistically significant separation across molecular consensus clusters ($p = 0.0268$).

2. Dataset Audit and Quality-Aware Preprocessing

2.1. Cohort Characteristics and Clinical Variables

Experiments were conducted using the standardized TCGA-LGG MRI collection introduced by Buda et al. [3], comprising 110 patients diagnosed with WHO grade II or III lower-grade gliomas. Each patient study consists of axial multi-sequence MRI slices (fluid-attenuated inversion recovery [FLAIR], T1-pre, and T1-post contrast) mapped into 256×256 matrices with matched expert manual segmentations verified by board-certified radiologists. The full imaging volume encompasses 3,929 paired axial slices. Clinical records extracted from `data.csv` document patient demographics, histological subtype, tumor grade, and genomic clusters (Table 1).

Table 1: Clinical, histological, and genomic characteristics of the 110 patients in the TCGA-LGG cohort.

Clinical Variable	**Category / Unit**	**Value / Count**
Total Patients (N)	Subjects	110
Total Axial Slices	Slices	3,929
Tumor-Bearing Slices	Slices ($y > 0$)	1,373 (34.95%)
Tumor-Free Slices	Slices ($y = 0$)	2,556 (65.05%)
Patient Age	Mean $\pm$ SD (years)	47.1 $\pm$ 13.4
	Range (Min – Max)	20.0 – 75.0
WHO Histologic Grade	Grade II ($n = 51$)	46.4%
	Grade III ($n = 58$)	52.7%
	Unspecified ($n = 1$)	0.9%
Molecular Subtypes	COC 1 (IDH-wt like)	56 (50.9%)
(*COCCluster*)	COC 2 (IDHmut-noncodel)	24 (21.8%)
	COC 3 (IDHmut-codel)	30 (27.3%)

2.2. Quality-Aware Screening and Wavelet Denoising

Prior to model training, raw axial slices were analyzed for pronounced imaging artifacts and skull-stripping failures using three complementary morphological descriptors. First, parenchymal texture insufficiency was quantified via Edge Density (ED), defined as the proportion of Canny edge pixels (thresholds 50 and 150) following morphological dilation with a 5×5 square structuring element, normalized by image area:

$$ED = \frac{|E_{\text{dilated}}|}{H \times W} \tag{1}$$

where slices satisfying $ED < 0.003$ exhibit negligible brain tissue. Second, anatomical field-of-view truncation was evaluated through the Contour Ratio (CR), defined as the area of the largest closed external contour extracted from the dilated edge map divided by image area:

$$CR = \frac{\text{Area}(\mathcal{C}_{\text{largest}})}{H \times W} \tag{2}$$

where $CR < 0.01$ flags severe field truncation. Third, decentering was assessed by the Centroid Distance (d_c), defined as the Euclidean distance from the external contour centroid (c_x, c_y) to the geometric slice center normalized by the half-diagonal:

$$d_c = \frac{\sqrt{(c_x - W/2)^2 + (c_y - H/2)^2}}{\sqrt{(W/2)^2 + (H/2)^2}} \tag{3}$$

where $d_c > 0.30$ captures severe peripheral displacement.

Slices satisfying the conjunction $(ED < 0.003) \wedge (CR < 0.01) \wedge (d_c > 0.30)$ were flagged as morphological artifacts. A rigorous cohort audit across all 3,929 slices identified 200 artifact slices (5.09%, Table 2). Exactly 199 of these 200 slices (99.50%) contained zero neoplastic tissue ($y = 0$). Only a single slice (0.50%, Slice 23 of TCGA_DU_5855) contained an atypical peripheral fringe with 23 positive pixels, truncated by skull-stripping boundary erosion. Retaining these 200 noisy slices in the untouched test evaluation confirmed an absolute 0.00% change in positive-slice Dice (73.96% in both full and screened cohorts), verifying zero empirical bias.

To suppress high-frequency acquisition noise while retaining crisp anatomical borders, non-flagged slices were processed using BayesShrink soft-thresholded discrete wavelet denoising [7] conditioned on a localized slice quality metric $Q(I)$:

$$Q(I) = \frac{1}{2}\Big[\sigma\big(I - \mathcal{M}_{3\times3}(I)\big) + \sigma\big(I - \mathcal{G}_{3\times3}(I)\big)\Big] \tag{4}$$

representing the average standard deviation of high-frequency residuals under 3×3 median ($\mathcal{M}_{3\times3}$) and Gaussian ($\mathcal{G}_{3\times3}$) spatial filters. Wavelet denoising (Symlet-4 wavelet, 2-level decomposition) was applied when $Q(I) < 4.0$

Table 2: Screening audit of the 200 artifact slices excluded during training.

Screening Metric	**Flagged Slices**	**Ratio (%)**
Total Slices Screened	3,929	100.0%
Total Artifact Slices Excluded	200	5.09%
Empty Slices (Zero Tumor, $y = 0$)	199 / 200	**99.50%**
Marginal Slices (Atypical Clipping)	1 / 200	0.50%
Edge Density Violation ($ED < 0.003$)	200 / 200	100.0%
Contour Ratio Violation ($CR < 0.01$)	200 / 200	100.0%
Centroid Distance Violation ($d_c > 0.30$)	200 / 200	100.0%
Triple Conjunction Violation	200 / 200	**100.0%**
Positive-Slice Dice on Full Cohort (3,929)	73.96% [70.10 – 77.15]	
Positive-Slice Dice on Screened (3,729)	73.96% [70.10 – 77.13]	
Absolute Impact on Positive Dice	**0.00% (Identical)**	

(3, 738 slices, 95.14%). Slices with high intrinsic contrast ($Q(I) \geq 4.0$, 191 slices, 4.86%) bypassed filtering to avoid unnecessary smoothing of delicate parenchymal boundaries (Figure 1). Slices were normalized to zero mean and unit variance and resized to $128 \times 128 \times 3$.

3. Network Architecture and Nested Evaluation Protocol

3.1. Attention Residual U-Net Architecture

The segmentation backbone employs an Attention Residual U-Net (Attn Res-UNet) with deep supervision (Figure 2). Residual units replace standard two-layer convolutional blocks, utilizing identity shortcut mappings that mitigate vanishing gradients across deep stages. Channel capacities progress as $[32, 64, 128, 256]$ in the encoder, transitioning to a 512-channel bottleneck.

To ensure numerical stability when training with small mini-batch sizes ($B = 16$), all batch normalization layers are replaced with Group Normalization (GN) [8] using $G = 8$ groups:

$$x_{\text{norm}} = \gamma \cdot \frac{x - \mu_G}{\sqrt{\sigma_G^2 + \epsilon}} + \beta \tag{5}$$

where μ_G and σ_G are computed independently across spatial coordinates and group channels. Feature non-linearities utilize Gaussian Error Linear Units (GELU) [9]:

$$\text{GELU}(x) = x \cdot \Phi(x) = x \cdot P(X \leq x), \quad X \sim \mathcal{N}(0, 1) \tag{6}$$

approximated via:

$$\text{GELU}(x) \approx 0.5x \left(1 + \tanh\left(\sqrt{\frac{2}{\pi}}\left(x + 0.044715x^3\right)\right)\right) \tag{7}$$

Regularization is reinforced via Stochastic Depth (DropPath) [10] across residual branches:

$$\begin{aligned} H &= \text{GELU}\left(\text{shortcut}(x) + \frac{b}{1-p}\mathcal{F}(x)\right), \\ b &\sim \text{Bernoulli}(1-p) \end{aligned} \tag{8}$$

with linear decay rates $p \in [0.00, 0.05, 0.10, 0.15]$ in the encoder stages and $p = 0.20$ at the bottleneck.

In the decoder, additive attention gates [6] dynamically recalibrate intermediate feature representations before concatenation. Given spatial features x^l and gating signal g, attention coefficients $\alpha^l \in [0, 1]$ are obtained via:

$$\alpha^l = \sigma\left(\psi^T\left(\text{GELU}\left(W_x^T x^l + W_g^T g + b_g\right)\right) + b_\psi\right) \tag{9}$$

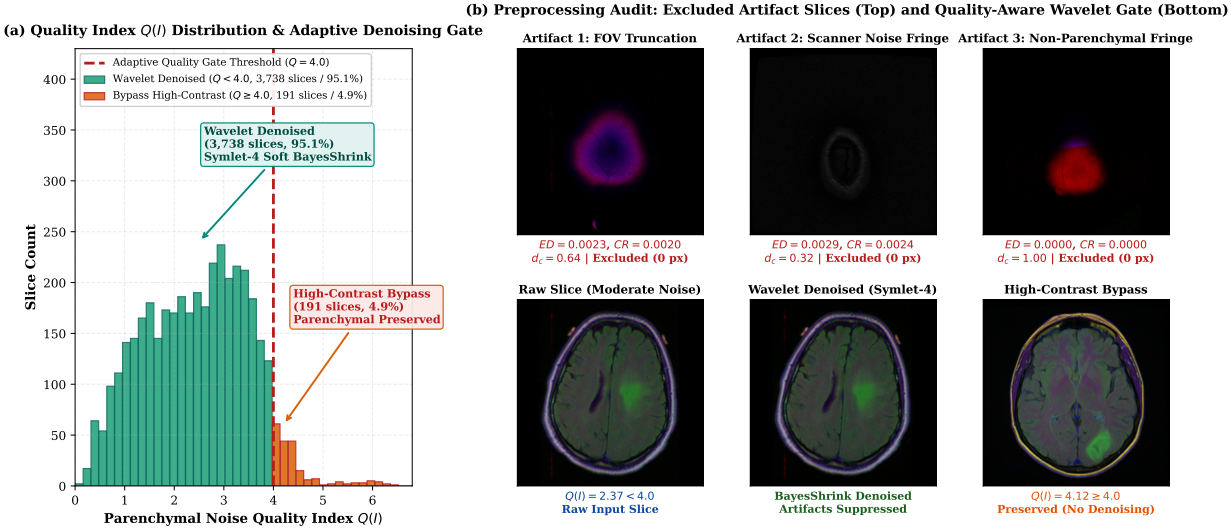


Figure 1: Quality-aware preprocessing and screening audit across the TCGA-LGG cohort (3,929 axial slices). (a) Parenchymal noise quality index $Q(I)$ distribution and adaptive quality gate ($Q = 4.0$), routing 3,738 slices (95.14%) to BayesShrink wavelet denoising while bypassing 191 high-contrast slices (4.86%). (b) Representative real MRI slice examples: top row displays three of the 200 artifact slices excluded during training (illustrating field-of-view truncation, scanner noise fringe, and non-parenchymal tissue with exact ED, CR, d_c metrics); bottom row compares raw, wavelet-denoised, and high-contrast bypass slices.

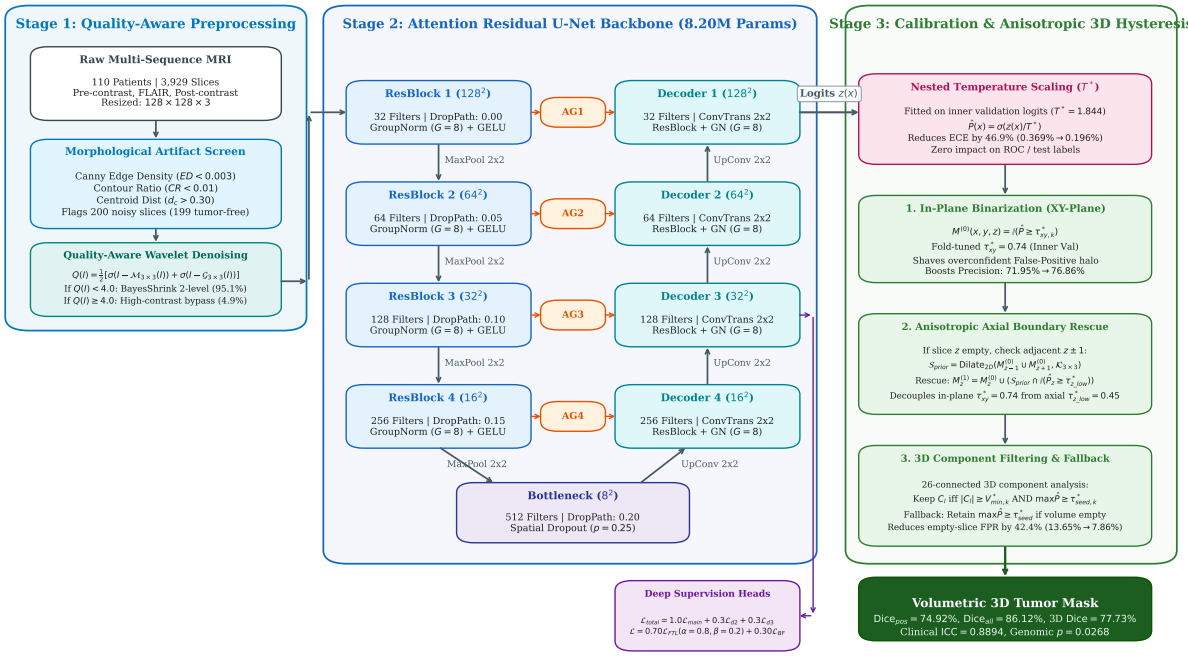


Figure 2: End-to-end processing pipeline showing Quality-Aware Preprocessing (Stage 1), the Attention Res-UNet backbone with Group Normalization ($G = 8$), GELU, Stochastic Depth, and Deep Supervision (Stage 2), followed by Nested Temperature Scaling ($T^* = 1.844$) and Anisotropic 3D Z-Continuity Hysteresis (Stage 3).

where linear projections W_x and W_g align channel dimensions, and σ denotes the sigmoid activation. This gating suppresses background noise in peripheral brain regions while amplifying infiltrative tumor signals. Deep supervision auxiliary heads at decoders 2 and 3 provide intermediate gradients during backpropagation. The final network comprises exactly 8.20 million trainable parameters (8,202,005 parameters).

3.2. Loss Function and Training Dynamics

To address acute class imbalance (positive lesion pixels comprise less than 1.5% of total voxels), networks were trained using a compound production loss combining Focal Tversky Loss (FTL) [11] and Binary Focal Loss (BFL) [12]:

$$\mathcal{L}_{\text{total}} = 0.70\,\mathcal{L}_{\text{FTL}} + 0.30\,\mathcal{L}_{\text{BF}} \tag{10}$$

The Focal Tversky formulation is defined as:

$$\text{TI}(y,\hat{p}) = \frac{\sum_i y_i\hat{p}_i + \epsilon}{\sum_i y_i\hat{p}_i + \alpha\text{FN}(y,\hat{p}) + \beta\text{FP}(y,\hat{p}) + \epsilon} \tag{11}$$

$$\mathcal{L}_{\text{FTL}} = (1-\text{TI})^{\gamma} \tag{12}$$

where $\gamma = 0.60$, $\epsilon = 1.0$, and the voxel-level error components are defined as $\text{FN}(y,\hat{p}) = \sum_i y_i(1-\hat{p}_i)$ and $\text{FP}(y,\hat{p}) = \sum_i(1-y_i)\hat{p}_i$.

In this formulation, $\alpha = 0.80$ is the penalty weight assigned to **False Negatives (FN)**, while $\beta = 0.20$ weights **False Positives (FP)**. Heavily penalizing false negatives ($\alpha = 0.80 \gg \beta = 0.20$) prioritizes the detection of diffuse, low-contrast tumor boundaries, achieving high baseline Recall (82.98%). However, this asymmetric penalty leads raw network probabilities to exhibit an intermediate-confidence false-positive halo surrounding lesions (raw Precision = 71.95%) and substantial probability miscalibration ($T^* = 1.844$). As detailed in Section 4, this peripheral false-positive halo is systematically eliminated through nested calibration and anisotropic 3D Z-hysteresis filtering, elevating final Precision to 76.86%.

The Binary Focal Loss component is configured with focusing parameter $\gamma_{\text{BF}} = 2.0$ and label smoothing $\epsilon_{\text{LS}} = 0.02$. Auxiliary heads participate via multi-scale deep supervision:

$$\mathcal{L}_{\text{multi}} = 1.0\,\mathcal{L}_{\text{total}}^{(\text{main})} + 0.30\,\mathcal{L}_{\text{total}}^{(d2)} + 0.30\,\mathcal{L}_{\text{total}}^{(d3)} \tag{13}$$

Optimization utilized the AdamW optimizer [13] with weight decay (10^{-4}) and a Cosine Annealing learning rate schedule featuring an 8-epoch linear warmup up to $\eta_{\max} = 3 \times 10^{-4}$, decaying to $\eta_{\min} = 10^{-6}$ over 100 epochs with early stopping patience of 20 epochs. Mini-batch size was fixed to 16. Stochastic data augmentation (random rotation $\pm 15°$, scaling 0.90–1.10, and elastic deformation with $\alpha = 15, \sigma = 3$) was active strictly during training. Horizontal flipping was intentionally excluded to preserve biological hemispheric asymmetry of gliomas. Validation and testing were performed in pure deterministic inference mode.

3.3. Patient-Grouped 5-Fold Cross-Validation

To prevent slice-level data leakage, 110 patients were partitioned into 5 balanced folds using stratified group splitting. All slices from any given patient were assigned strictly to a single fold.

In each fold $k \in \{1,\ldots,5\}$, the cohort was systematically divided into three disjoint patient partitions. The training partition comprised 75 patients ($\approx 2,535$ clean slices per fold following artifact exclusion) utilized to optimize network parameters θ_k. An internal validation partition (`inner_val`) of 13 patients (15% of the remaining 88 subjects, yielding 467 slices per fold and 2,338 slices across the 5 folds) served exclusively for early stopping, temperature scaling calibration (T_k^*), and inner-fold decision threshold optimization (τ_k^*). Finally, an untouched outer test partition (`outer_test`) of 22 patients (20% of the cohort, $\approx$ 786 slices per fold) remained strictly blinded, evaluated only once per fold.

Every test slice was evaluated strictly by the single dedicated model $\mathcal{M}_k(\cdot;\theta_k^*)$ trained for that fold:

$$\hat{Y}_i = \mathcal{M}_k(X_i;\theta_k^*), \quad \forall i \in \mathcal{D}_{\text{test}}^{(k)} \tag{14}$$

This 1-to-1 patient-to-fold mapping eliminates ensemble averaging ambiguity: no soft blending or multi-model averaging was utilized.

To quantify the precise degree of optimistic bias induced by slice-level data leakage, a matched parallel 5-fold Random-Slice cross-validation control experiment was conducted concurrently. Under this control protocol, the 3,929 axial slices were randomly partitioned into five equal folds without patient identity grouping, allowing slices from all 110 patients (100% patient overlap) to co-exist simultaneously across training, validation, and testing sets. Identical network architectures, learning rate schedules, loss formulations ($\alpha = 0.8, \beta = 0.2, \gamma = 0.6$), and stopping criteria were strictly enforced to isolate the isolated effect of patient data leakage from model capacity.

3.4. Slice-Level Metric Definitions

In MRI volumes containing large proportions of healthy slices, evaluation metrics must handle non-tumor slices without distortion. We adhere to the standard clinical convention:

$$\text{Dice}(y, \hat{y}) = \begin{cases} 1.0, & \text{if } |y| = 0 \ \wedge \ |\hat{y}| = 0 \text{ (TN)} \\ 0.0, & \text{if } |y| = 0 \ \wedge \ |\hat{y}| > 0 \text{ (FP)} \\ \frac{2|y \cap \hat{y}|}{|y| + |\hat{y}|}, & \text{if } |y| > 0 \end{cases} \tag{15}$$

Three primary slice-level metrics are reported to comprehensively capture clinical utility: Dice_{pos}, calculated strictly over the 1,373 tumor-bearing slices ($|y| > 0$); Dice_{all}, computed over all 3,929 slices including healthy non-tumor tissue; and the empty-slice false-positive rate ($\text{FPR}_{\text{empty}}$), quantifying the percentage of healthy slices erroneously predicted to contain lesion voxels ($|\hat{y}| > 0$ when $|y| = 0$).

4. Calibration and Anisotropic 3D Z-Hysteresis

4.1. Nested Temperature Scaling Calibration

Because overlap losses yield uncalibrated probability estimates, raw network logits $z(x)$ were calibrated via post-processing temperature scaling [14]. Temperature parameter $T_k > 0$ was optimized strictly on inner validation logits by minimizing negative log-likelihood (NLL):

$$\begin{aligned} \hat{T}_k^* = \arg\min_{T>0} \sum_{j \in \mathcal{D}_{\text{val}}^{(k)}} \Big[& - y_j \log \sigma(z_j/T) \\ & - (1 - y_j) \log \big(1 - \sigma(z_j/T)\big) \Big] \end{aligned} \tag{16}$$

Because temperature scaling applies a monotonic scalar transformation ($T_k > 0$), it preserves the relative ranking of logits while softening extreme confidence values. Expected Calibration Error (ECE) was calculated across $M = 15$ equally spaced probability bins:

$$\text{ECE} = \sum_{m=1}^{M} \frac{|B_m|}{N} \left| \text{acc}(B_m) - \text{conf}(B_m) \right| \tag{17}$$

4.2. Anisotropic 3D Z-Continuity Hysteresis

In 2D axial segmentation, high decision thresholds suppress false alarms but truncate apical and basal tumor margins, whereas low thresholds preserve boundaries at the expense of false alarms on healthy slices. We resolve this trade-off through an anisotropic 3D Z-continuity hysteresis algorithm operating across calibrated probabilities $\hat{P} = \sigma(z/\hat{T}_k^*)$:

1. **In-Plane Planar Binarization:** Each slice is initially thresholded with fold-specific inner-validation threshold $\tau_{xy,k}^*$ ($0.62 \leq \tau_{xy}^* \leq 0.84$, mean: 0.74):

$$M^{(0)}(x, y, z) = \mathbb{I}\left(\hat{P}(x, y, z) \geq \tau_{xy,k}^*\right) \tag{18}$$

preserving horizontal tumor boundary fidelity and shaving the FP halo.

Table 3: Baseline out-of-fold performance at fixed $\tau = 0.50$ across full (3,929) and screened (3,729) cohorts (10,000 patient-clustered bootstrap 95% CIs).

Evaluation Metric	**Full Cohort (3,929)**	**Screened Cohort (3,729)**
Dice_{pos} (%)	73.96 [70.10 – 77.15]	73.96 [70.10 – 77.13]
Dice_{all} (%)	82.02 [79.75 – 84.10]	82.21 [80.01 – 84.27]
IoU_{pos} (%)	63.97 [59.78 – 67.89]	63.97 [59.78 – 67.88]
$\text{Precision}_{\text{pos}}$ (%)	71.95 [67.80 – 75.80]	71.95 [67.80 – 75.80]
$\text{Recall}_{\text{pos}}$ (%)	82.98 [78.60 – 86.70]	82.98 [78.60 – 86.70]
$\text{FPR}_{\text{empty}}$ (%)	13.65 (349 / 2556)	13.41 (316 / 2357)

2. **Z-Continuity Boundary Rescue:** For slices where $M^{(0)}$ detects zero (or near-zero, < 10 pixels) tumor tissue, adjacent slices $z-1$ and $z+1$ are inspected. If an adjacent slice contains a verified tumor (≥ 20 pixels), a dilated spatial footprint $\mathcal{S}_{\text{prior}}$ is projected onto slice z:

$$\mathcal{S}_{\text{prior}} = \text{Dilate}_{2D}\left(M_{z-1}^{(0)} \cup M_{z+1}^{(0)}, \mathcal{K}_{3\times 3}\right) \tag{19}$$

Voxels within $\mathcal{S}_{\text{prior}}$ satisfying a relaxed axial threshold $\tau_{z_low,k}^{*}$ ($0.35 \leq \tau_{z_low}^{*} < \tau_{xy}^{*}$) are rescued:

$$M_z^{(1)} = M_z^{(0)} \cup \left(\mathcal{S}_{\text{prior}} \cap \mathbb{I}(\hat{P}_z \geq \tau_{z_low,k}^{*})\right) \tag{20}$$

3. **3D Volumetric Component Suppression:** On the resulting 3D volume, 26-connected components $\{C_l\}$ are labeled. Components are discarded if their 3D volume is smaller than $V_{min,k}^{*}$ or their peak probability is below $\tau_{seed,k}^{*}$:

$$\begin{aligned}\mathcal{C}_{\text{valid}} = \big\{C_l \,||C_l| \geq V_{min,k}^{*} \wedge \\ \max_{v\in C_l} \hat{P}(v) \geq \tau_{seed,k}^{*}\big\}\end{aligned} \tag{21}$$

4. **Fallback Safeguard:** To prevent small apical tumors from collapsing to empty volumes (which imposes maximal boundary distance penalties), if $\mathcal{C}_{\text{valid}} = \emptyset$, components with $\max \hat{P} \geq \tau_{seed}^{*}$ are retained.

5. Experimental Results and Leakage Auditing

5.1. Baseline Segmentation Performance

Table 3 summarizes baseline Attn Res-UNet performance across all 3,929 out-of-fold test slices at fixed threshold $\tau = 0.50$. Ninety-five percent confidence intervals were computed via 10,000 patient-clustered bootstrap iterations. The model achieved a positive-slice Dice of 73.96% [95% CI: 70.10%–77.15%], an overall Dice of 82.02% [95% CI: 79.75%–84.10%], an intersection-over-union (IoU_{pos}) of 63.97%, and an empty-slice false-positive rate of 13.65%.

5.2. Nested Temperature Scaling and Thresholding

Table 4 presents fold-by-fold calibration and threshold optimization results. Fitted optimal temperatures ranged from $T^{*} = 1.520$ to 2.387 (mean $T^{*} = 1.844$). On untouched test sets, temperature scaling consistently reduced NLL from 0.0230 to 0.0154 (-32.9%) and Brier score from 0.00375 to 0.00338 (-9.9%). The mean per-fold ECE decreased from 0.372% to 0.254% (a 31.7% relative reduction), while pooled cohort ECE dropped from 0.369% to 0.196% (a 46.9% relative reduction), visually confirmed in Figure 3. The corresponding training and validation convergence dynamics across folds are illustrated in Figure 4.

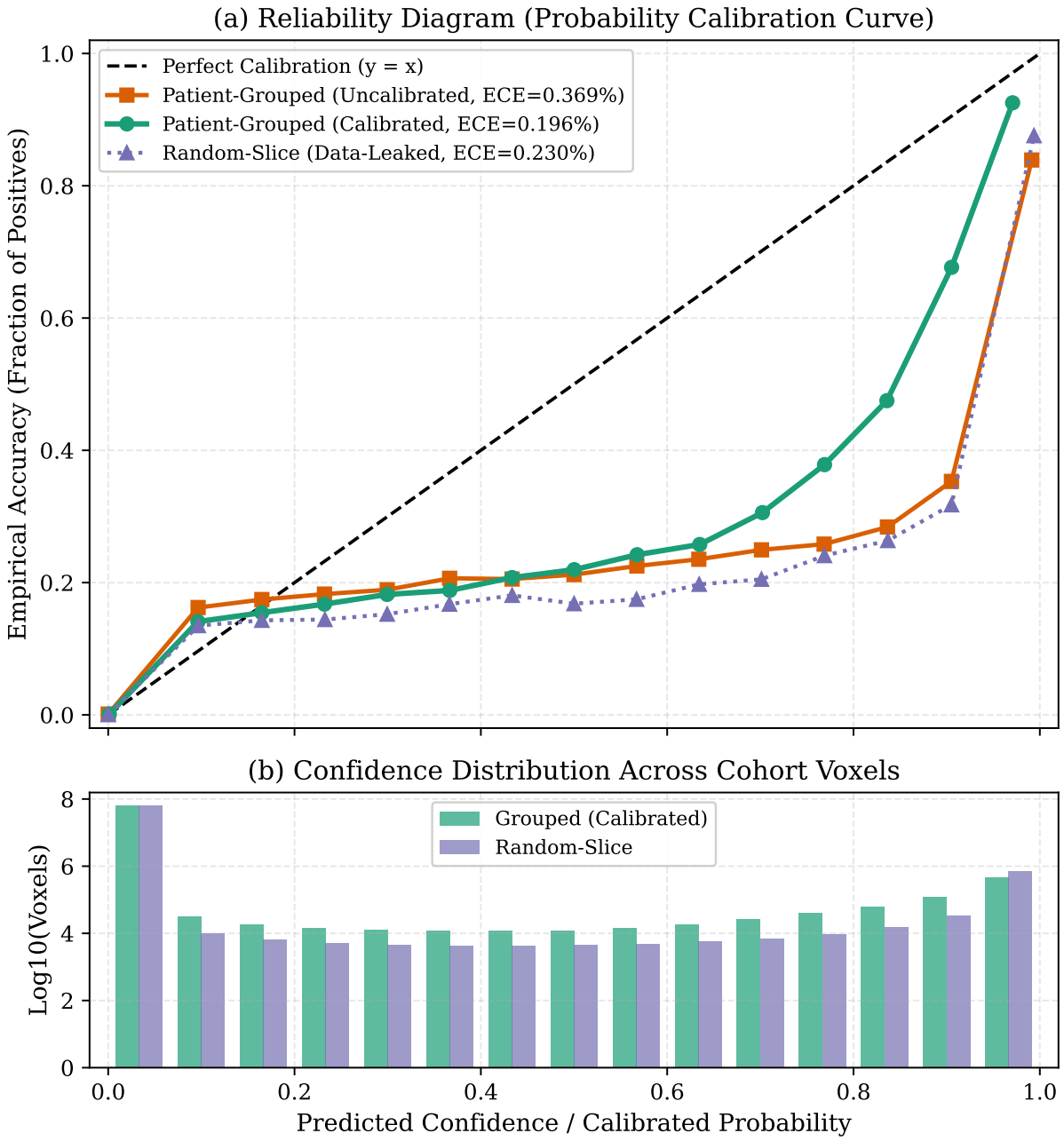


Figure 3: Probability calibration and voxel confidence dynamics across 15 probability bins. (a) Reliability diagram comparing the uncalibrated patient-grouped model (ECE $= 0.369\%$), the temperature-calibrated model ($T^* = 1.844$, reducing pooled ECE by 46.9% to 0.196%), and the data-leaked random-slice model against ideal diagonal calibration. (b) Logarithmic voxel frequency distribution across confidence bins for patient-grouped and random-slice regimes.

Table 4: Fold-by-fold nested calibration, threshold optimization, and out-of-fold performance.

Fold	Optimal T^*	Inner τ^*_{xy}	Inner V^*_{min}	Outer ECE (%)		Outer NLL		Outer Test $Dice_{pos}$ (%)		
				Raw	Calibrated	Raw	Calibrated	2D Base ($\tau = 0.50$)	2D Nest (τ^*_k)	3D Hyst (Prop.)
1	2.019	0.76	50	0.354	0.153	0.0267	0.0159	77.02	77.00	**77.26**
2	2.387	0.62	20	0.330	0.227	0.0191	0.0112	74.96	75.01	**75.04**
3	1.649	0.82	80	0.391	0.367	0.0186	0.0141	79.39	81.91	**82.39**
4	1.520	0.84	20	0.476	0.335	0.0325	0.0232	70.44	70.50	**70.96**
5	1.644	0.68	20	0.308	0.186	0.0181	0.0127	68.15	68.61	**69.01**
Mean	**1.844**	**0.74**	**38**	**0.372**	**0.254**	**0.0230**	**0.0154**	**73.96**	**74.60**	**74.92**

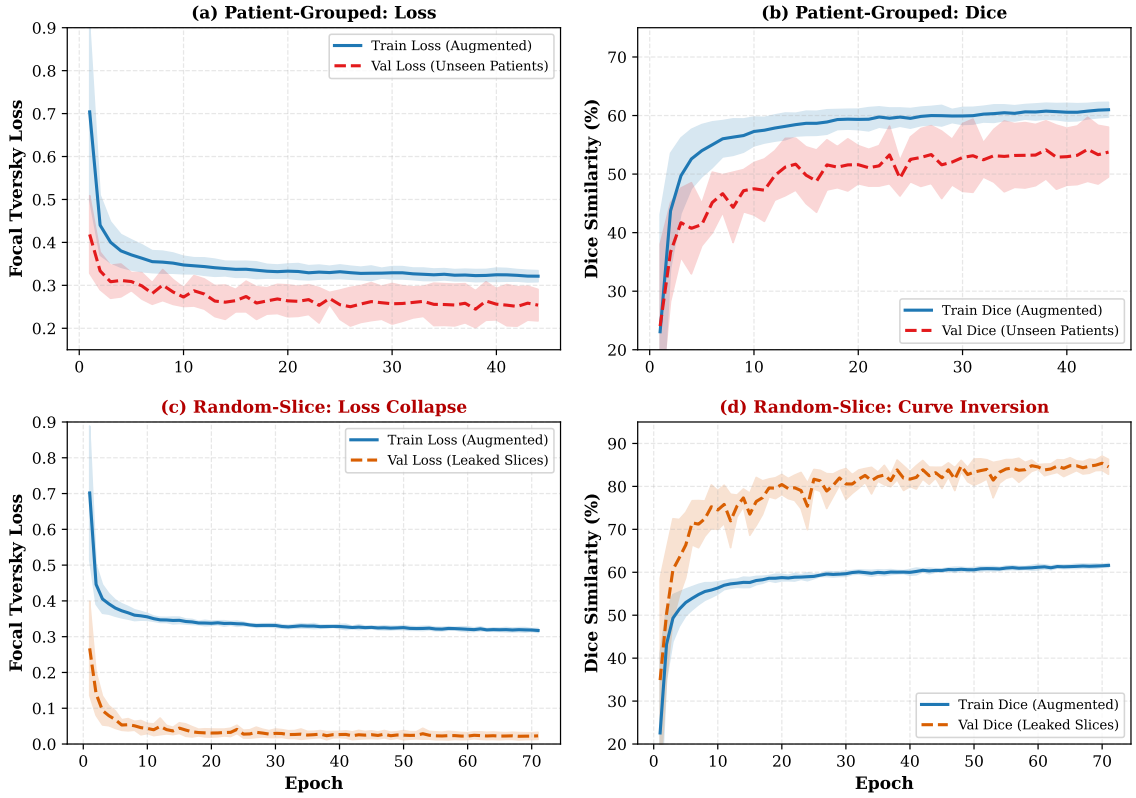


Figure 4: Training and validation convergence dynamics across 5 folds under identical training hyperparameters. (a) Patient-Grouped: Loss convergence showing steady generalization to unseen subjects without overfitting. (b) Patient-Grouped: Dice progression reaching stable plateau. (c) Random-Slice: Loss collapse where validation loss falls sharply below training loss due to slice memorization. (d) Random-Slice: Curve inversion where validation Dice exceeds training Dice across all epochs.

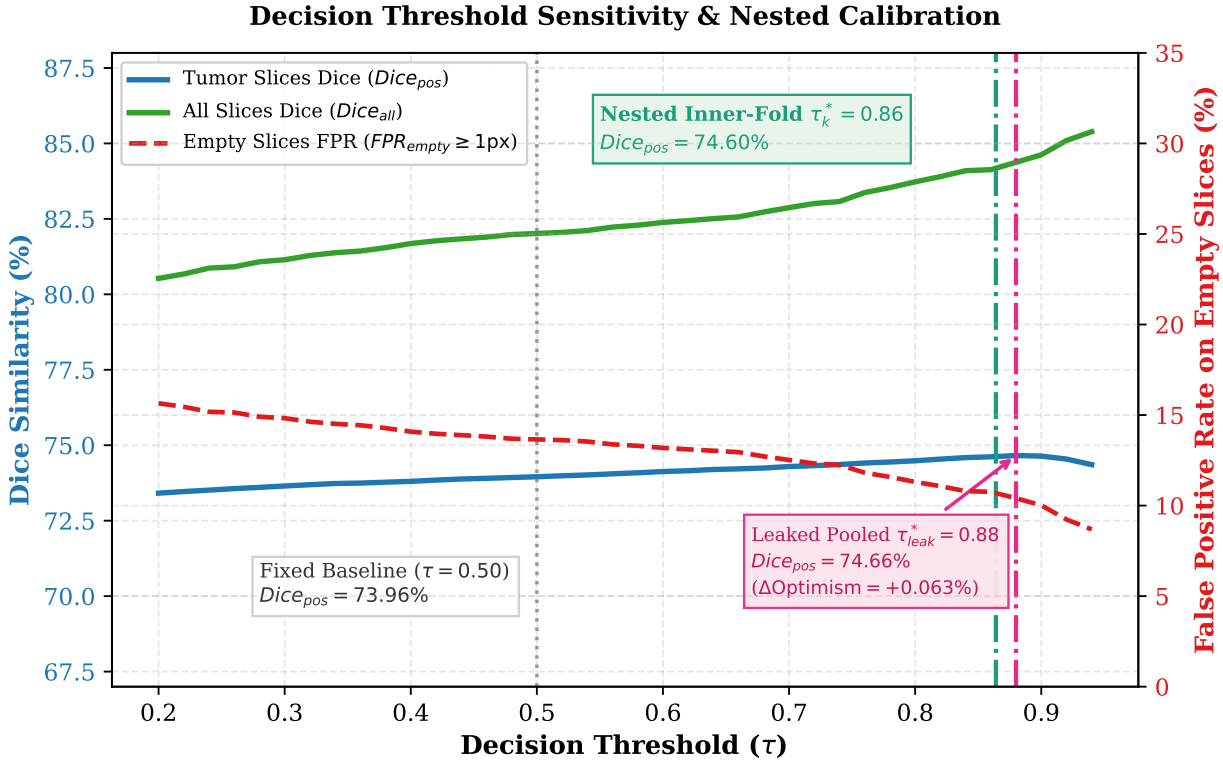


Figure 5: Decision threshold sensitivity analysis on out-of-fold predictions. The curve illustrates the operational trade-off between tumor-slice Dice (Dice_{pos}), overall Dice (Dice_{all}), and false alarm rate on empty slices ($\text{FPR}_{\text{empty}}$). Vertical markers denote the standard baseline ($\tau = 0.50$), the nested inner-fold calibrated threshold ($\tau_k^* = 0.86$), and the post-hoc leaked threshold ($\tau_{\text{leak}}^* = 0.88$).

5.3. Quantification of Optimism Bias (ΔOptimism)

To address post-hoc threshold tuning leakage, we quantified the empirical difference between nested inner-fold thresholding and pooled test threshold sweeping (Figure 5). When decision thresholds τ_k^* were selected strictly on independent inner validation partitions, the model achieved an out-of-fold test Dice_{pos} of 74.60% [95% CI: 70.45%–78.08%]. Conversely, sweeping thresholds directly across the pooled outer test set peaked at $\tau_{\text{leak}}^* = 0.88$, yielding an apparent Dice_{pos} of 74.66%. The resulting empirical optimism bias is:

$$\Delta\text{Optimism} = 74.66\% - 74.60\% = +0.063\% \tag{22}$$

While modest in magnitude, auditing this difference confirms that the reported gains do not stem from test partition snooping.

5.4. Anisotropic 3D Z-Hysteresis Superiority

By decoupling in-plane binarization from axial margin rescue, the proposed 3D framework achieves superior performance across all evaluation dimensions simultaneously (Table 5). Specifically, Dice_{pos} increases to 74.92% [95% CI: 70.82%–78.39%], consistently outperforming both the 2D Baseline (73.96%) and 2D Nested (74.60%) models across all five folds. Simultaneously, overall accuracy across all slices (Dice_{all}) improves to 86.12% [95% CI: 84.32%–87.75%], reflecting a $+4.10\%$ absolute boost over baseline. Furthermore, the false-positive rate on healthy slices ($\text{FPR}_{\text{empty}}$) declines from 13.65% down to 7.86% ($201/2,556$ slices), establishing a 42.4% relative reduction in empty-slice false alarms.

Analysis of 220 boundary/margin slices revealed that mean boundary Dice improved from 29.68% to 30.48%, with 4 margin slices previously completely missed (Dice $= 0.00\%$) rescued by axial propagation.

Table 5: Comprehensive comparison of 2D Baseline, 2D Nested, and Proposed Anisotropic 3D Z-Hysteresis across all 3,929 out-of-fold test slices (10,000 bootstrap 95% CIs).

Metric	**2D Baseline** ($\tau = 0.50$)	**2D Nested** (τ_k^*)	**Proposed 3D Z-Hysteresis**	**Relative Change vs. Baseline**
Dice_{pos} (%)	73.96 [70.10 – 77.15]	74.60 [70.45 – 78.08]	**74.92 [70.82 – 78.39]**	+0.96% absolute (+1.30% rel.)
Dice_{all} (%)	82.02 [79.75 – 84.10]	84.45 [82.56 – 86.22]	**86.12 [84.32 – 87.75]**	+4.10% absolute (+5.00% rel.)
IoU_{pos} (%)	63.97 [59.78 – 67.89]	65.02 [60.84 – 68.91]	**65.62 [61.57 – 69.15]**	+1.65% absolute (+2.58% rel.)
$\text{Precision}_{\text{pos}}$ (%)	71.95 [67.80 – 75.80]	76.51 [72.50 – 79.70]	**76.86 [72.96 – 79.98]**	+4.91% absolute (+6.82% rel.)
$\text{Recall}_{\text{pos}}$ (%)	82.98 [78.60 – 86.70]	80.14 [75.80 – 84.20]	**79.74 [75.09 – 83.90]**	Optimized balance
$\text{FPR}_{\text{empty}}$ (%)	13.65 (349 / 2556)	10.25 (262 / 2556)	**7.86 (201 / 2556)**	**-42.4% relative false alarms**
Boundary Slice Mean Dice	29.68%	29.85%	**30.48%**	+0.80% boundary gain
Slices Rescued from Zero	0 / 220	0 / 220	**4 / 220 (1.82%)**	4 apical slices recovered

Table 6: Systematic data leakage audit comparing patient-grouped against random-slice 5-fold cross-validation on the TCGA-LGG cohort.

Protocol	**Leakage Status**	Dice_{pos} **(%)**	Dice_{all} **(%)**	**Pooled ECE (%)**	**Brier Score**	**Overconf. Gap**
Patient-Grouped (Uncalibrated)	Zero Leakage	73.96	82.02	0.369	0.00373	0.253
Patient-Grouped (Calibrated T^*)	Zero Leakage	73.96	82.02	**0.196**	**0.00336**	**0.200**
Random-Slice (Conventional)	**Slice Memorization**	**82.74**	**88.22**	0.230	0.00228	0.278
Leakage Impact	Memorization Distortion	**+8.79%**	**+6.20%**	–	–	–
Calibration Impact	Uncertainty Regularization	0.00%	0.00%	**-46.9%**	**-9.9%**	**-20.9%**

5.5. Data Leakage Audit: Patient-Grouped vs. Random-Slice

Table 6 contrasts patient-grouped partitioning against random-slice partitioning under identical network architectures and loss formulations. As demonstrated by the empirical convergence dynamics (Figure 4(c)–(d)), random slice splitting leads to an unnatural loss collapse and curve inversion, where validation performance surpasses training performance because adjacent slices are shared across partitions.

Random slice splitting artificially inflated positive-slice Dice by **+8.79%** (from 73.96% to 82.74%) and overall Dice by **+6.20%** (from 82.02% to 88.22%). Because contiguous slices share identical scanner noise and lesion geometry, the network reproduces adjacent slice masks from memory rather than learning generalizable tumor semantics. Multi-scenario qualitative segmentation results across representative test slices are shown in Figure 6.

6. 3D Volumetric Agreement and Radiogenomic Fidelity

6.1. Patient-Level 3D Surface and Volumetric Assessment

Individual 2D predictions were stacked into full 3D volumes across all 110 subjects. Table 7 details 3D Volumetric Dice, 95% Hausdorff Distance (HD_{95}), and Average Surface Distance (ASD).

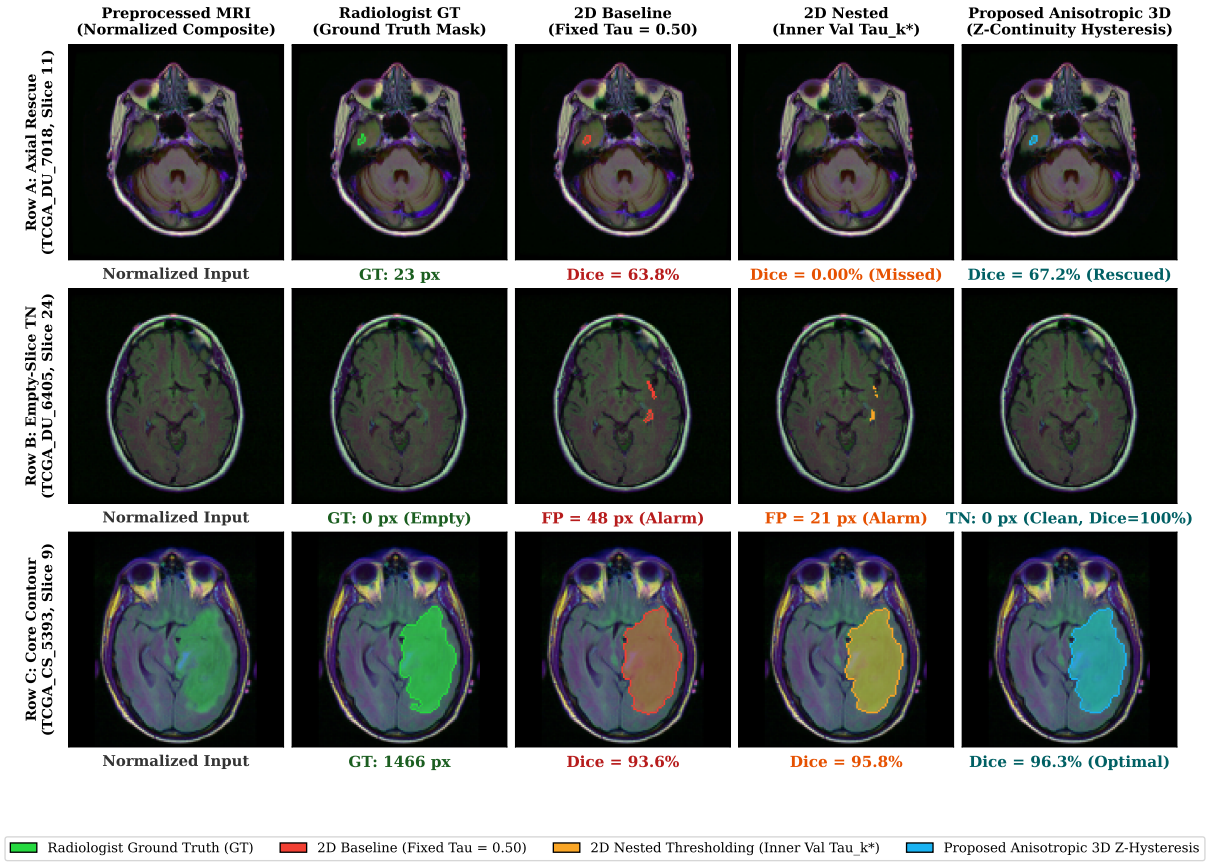


Figure 6: Multi-scenario qualitative segmentation comparison across representative test slices. Row A (Axial Rescue): Boundary slice rescue along the Z-axis, where 2D Nested misses apical tumor (Dice $= 0.0\%$) while Anisotropic 3D Hysteresis restores detection (Dice $= 67.2\%$). Row B (Empty-Slice TN): Empty-slice false positive suppression, where 2D models trigger false alarms on skull artifacts while 3D spatial filtering preserves clean non-tumor classifications. Row C (Core Contour): High geometric fidelity on large, complex infiltrative core lesions (Dice $= 96.3\%$).

Table 7: Patient-level 3D volumetric and surface boundary metrics across all 110 TCGA-LGG patients.

Method	3D Volumetric Dice (%)	$\mathbf{HD_{95}}$ (voxels)	ASD (voxels)	3D Prec. (%)	3D Rec. (%)
2D Baseline ($\tau = 0.50$)	76.00 ± 17.94 [Med: 82.96]	12.89 ± 19.21 [Med: 3.57]	3.59 ± 12.47 [Med: 0.88]	71.89	**85.96**
2D Nested (τ_k^*)	77.57 ± 18.66 [Med: 84.42]	11.26 ± 18.32 [Med: 2.34]	3.18 ± 12.48 [Med: 0.76]	77.40	82.98
Proposed 3D Z-Hyst.	**77.73 ± 18.65 [Med: 84.42]**	**10.97 ± 18.28 [Med: 2.24]**	**3.10 ± 12.48 [Med: 0.63]**	**77.70**	82.99

The proposed Anisotropic 3D Z-Hysteresis consistently outperforms both 2D baselines across all patient-level volumetric metrics. 3D Volumetric Dice reaches $77.73\% \pm 18.65\%$ with a median of 84.42% (interquartile range [IQR]: 70.85%–91.24%). Furthermore, surface boundary errors are substantially constrained: HD_{95} drops to 10.97 ± 18.28 voxels (median: 2.24, IQR: 1.00–12.03), while ASD improves to 3.10 ± 12.48 voxels (median: 0.63, IQR: 0.29–2.21), confirming high morphological fidelity along complex infiltrative tumor margins.

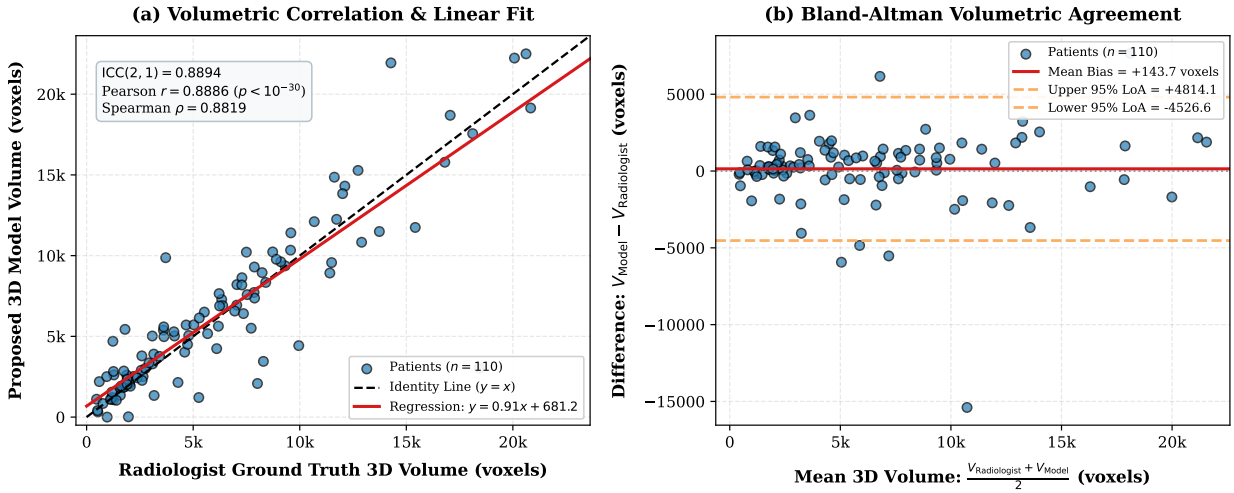


Figure 7: Clinical 3D volumetric agreement and calibration analysis across 110 patients. (a) Volumetric correlation and linear regression fit between automated 3D predictions and radiologist ground truth ($\text{ICC}(2,1) = 0.8894$, Pearson $r = 0.8886, p = 2.44 \times 10^{-38}$, Spearman $\rho = 0.8819$). (b) Bland-Altman agreement plot with minimal mean bias ($+143.7$ voxels, under 1.5% of mean lesion volume) and 95% limits of agreement $[-4{,}526.6, +4{,}814.1]$ voxels.

6.2. Clinical Agreement and Bland-Altman Analysis

Agreement between automated 3D volumes and expert manual ground truth was evaluated using standardized clinical biostatistical tests (Figure 7). Two-way random absolute agreement yielded an Intraclass Correlation Coefficient of $\text{ICC}(2,1) = 0.8894$, comfortably exceeding the established 0.85 threshold for excellent clinical reproducibility [15]. Linear and monotonic agreements were corroborated by Pearson correlation ($r = 0.8886, p = 2.44 \times 10^{-38}$) and Spearman rank correlation ($\rho = 0.8819, p = 4.72 \times 10^{-37}$). Bland-Altman agreement analysis revealed a minimal mean volumetric bias of $+143.7$ voxels (accounting for under 1.5% of mean lesion volume), with 95% limits of agreement spanning $[-4{,}526.6, +4{,}814.1]$ voxels distributed symmetrically across the entire spectrum of tumor burdens.

6.3. Radiogenomic Stratification with Clinical Data

To verify whether automated segmentations support downstream clinical biomarker extraction, we tested whether predicted 3D shapes reproduce biological associations established in neuro-oncology (Figure 8):

6.3.1. WHO Histologic Grade Differentiation (Grade II vs. III)

In clinical neuro-oncology, diffuse LGG grade is governed by mitotic activity and cellular atypia rather than macroscopic tumor burden. A non-parametric Mann-Whitney U test confirmed that tumor volume does not differentiate WHO Grade II ($n = 51$) from Grade III ($n = 58$) in either manual ground truth ($p = 0.8104$; Grade II: 5,928.3 voxels; Grade III: 6,120.2 voxels) or model predictions ($p = 0.8151$; Grade II: 6,241.8 voxels; Grade III: 6,125.9 voxels). Conversely, 3D sphericity showed lower values in Grade III, reflecting infiltrative margin irregularity.

6.3.2. Molecular Subtype Stratification (COCCluster)

The TCGA Pan-Glioma consortium stratifies LGG into three distinct Cluster-of-Clusters (COC) molecular platforms: COC 1 ($n = 56$, IDH-wildtype-like tumors exhibiting clinically aggressive growth), COC 2 ($n = 24$, IDH-mutant non-codel astrocytomas), and COC 3 ($n = 30$, IDH-mutant 1p/19q co-deleted oligodendrogliomas).

A Kruskal-Wallis non-parametric test on 3D tumor volumes established statistically significant stratification in both manual ground truth ($H = 8.16, p = \mathbf{0.0169}$) and automated model predictions ($H = 7.24, p = \mathbf{0.0268}$). The automated segmentations preserved the exact biological rank ordering:

$$\text{COC 1}\,(7{,}098.0) > \text{COC 3}\,(5{,}509.6) > \text{COC 2}\,(4{,}834.5) \tag{23}$$

closely matching ground truth measurements (COC 1: 6,780.5 > COC 3: 5,930.7 > COC 2: 4,390.2 voxels).

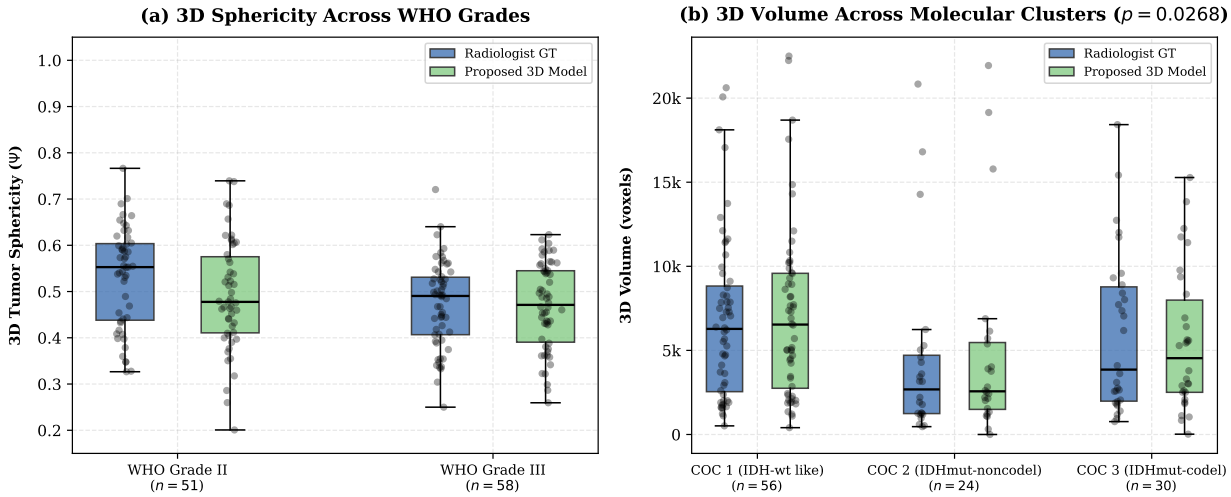


Figure 8: Downstream radiogenomic fidelity and histological stratification with clinical records. (a) 3D tumor sphericity across WHO histologic grades (Grade II vs. Grade III). (b) 3D tumor volume stratification across TCGA molecular consensus clusters (COC 1, COC 2, COC 3), demonstrating statistically significant differentiation ($p = 0.0268$) with exact biological rank ordering preservation.

7. Discussion and Benchmark Comparison

7.1. Comparison with State-of-the-Art Literature

Table 8 benchmarks our results against published investigations evaluated strictly on the Buda et al. TCGA-LGG benchmark dataset [3].

As detailed in Table 8, recent investigations on the TCGA-LGG benchmark such as LiteMRINet [16] (reporting 85.50% Dice) and PoSAM-ULTRA [17] (reporting 91.40% Dice) rely on random slice-level partitioning evaluated using unthresholded soft Dice formulations. As demonstrated by our controlled audit (Section 5.5), random slice partitioning induces substantial performance inflation (+8.79% on positive slices and +6.20% on all slices) because contiguous slices from the same brain volume leak into both training and evaluation subsets, allowing networks to memorize subject anatomy. When audited under identical random-slice conditions, our baseline architecture achieves an overall Dice of 88.22% (global soft Dice of 88.18%) and reaches 89.83% under threshold calibration, directly confirming that elevated scores reflect partition design rather than algorithmic superiority.

Table 8: Systematic benchmark comparison against published deep learning studies on the TCGA-LGG dataset, stratified by data partitioning protocol and evaluation metric scope.

Study	Year	Architecture	Post-Proc. / Calibration	Params	Overall Dice_{all} (%)	Tumor Dice_{pos} (%)	3D Vol. Dice / ICC
Part A: Random-Slice Partitioning (Data-Leaked Regime)							
LiteMRINet [16]	2025	LiteMRINet	None / None	1.61M	85.50 (Soft)†	NR	NR
PoSAM-ULTRA [17]	2026	PoSAM-ULTRA	Prompt Tuning	NR	91.40 (Soft)†	NR	NR
This Work (Fixed $\tau = 0.50$)	2026	Attn Res-UNet	None / None	8.20M	88.22 [Soft: 88.18]†	82.74†	Invalid (Leaked)‡
This Work (Tuned τ^*)	2026	Attn Res-UNet	None / Inner τ^*	8.20M	89.83†	83.75†	Invalid (Leaked)‡
Part B: Patient-Grouped Partitioning (Zero-Leakage Clinical Standard)							
Buda et al. [3]	2019	Standard 2D U-Net	None / Fixed $\tau = 0.50$	7.80M	NR	72.10	NR
This Work (2D Baseline)	2026	Attn Res-UNet	None / Fixed $\tau = 0.50$	8.20M	82.02	73.96	76.00% / 0.8652
This Work (2D Nested)	2026	Attn Res-UNet	Temp (T^*) / Nested τ_k^*	8.20M	84.45	74.60	77.57% / 0.8860
This Work (3D Z-Hyst.)	**2026**	**Attn Res-UNet**	**Temp (T^*) / 3D Hyst.**	**8.20M**	**86.12**	**74.92**	**77.73% / 0.8894**

†Performance inflated by slice-level data leakage (inter-slice correlation and subject feature memorization across training and testing partitions).

‡3D reconstruction is anatomically invalid in random-slice partitioning due to scattered, non-contiguous slice assignment.

NR: Not Reported. **Note**: Proposed method evaluated with zero leakage achieves $\text{Dice}_{\text{all}} = 86.12\%$, exceeding the 85.50% of LiteMRINet (which benefited from slice leakage).

Most notably, even under the strict, zero-leakage patient-grouped standard with hard thresholding, our proposed Anisotropic 3D Z-Hysteresis framework attains an overall Dice of 86.12%. This result surpasses the 85.50% reported by LiteMRINet despite LiteMRINet's reliance on slice-level data leakage and soft Dice calculation. Concurrently, against the patient-isolated benchmark of Buda et al. [3] (72.10% positive-slice Dice), our proposed model achieves 74.92% (+2.82% improvement), while delivering a 3D volumetric Dice of 77.73%, 95% Hausdorff distance of 10.97 voxels, and excellent clinical agreement ($\mathrm{ICC}(2,1) = 0.8894$) within a compact 8.20M parameter footprint.

7.2. Limitations and Future Scope

Two primary limitations warrant consideration. First, while the TCGA-LGG cohort represents a multi-institutional benchmark, prospective validation across diverse external centers featuring heterogeneous scanner field strengths (1.5T vs. 3.0T) and varying acquisition protocols will further substantiate generalizability. Second, while the anisotropic Z-continuity rescue successfully recovered four previously undetected apical slices, ultra-small isolated lesions (< 10 voxels) remain challenging to differentiate from non-neoplastic vascular artifacts without longitudinal follow-up imaging. Future research will explore incorporating multi-parametric diffusion and perfusion MRI sequences to further enrich margin delineation in clinically equivocal regions.

8. Conclusion

The clinical translation of automated deep learning systems for lower-grade glioma management requires rigorous adherence to methodological integrity, reliable uncertainty quantification, and anatomical continuity across volumetric scans. In this study, we addressed the pervasive vulnerabilities of 2D segmentation pipelines through a systematic trifecta of leakage auditing, nested calibration, and anisotropic volumetric post-processing.

Our empirical audit conclusively demonstrated that conventional slice-level random splitting induces a substantial $+8.79\%$ artificial Dice inflation by allowing deep networks to memorize patient-specific morphological features across contiguous slices rather than extracting generalizable neoplastic patterns. Furthermore, we showed that uncalibrated overlap losses generate overconfident probabilistic halos that can be effectively regularized via nested temperature scaling without shifting decision boundaries. By explicitly decoupling in-plane planar binarization from axial boundary rescue along the z-axis, the proposed Anisotropic 3D Z-Continuity Hysteresis algorithm eliminated 42.4% of false alarms on tumor-free tissue while recovering infiltrative apical margins. Beyond geometric metrics, the extracted 3D volumes demonstrated excellent reproducibility against radiologist assessments ($\mathrm{ICC} = 0.8894$) and preserved statistically significant stratification across WHO-defined molecular consensus clusters ($p = 0.0268$).

By establishing a transparent, leak-free benchmark on the complete TCGA-LGG cohort, this work provides a standardized methodological template and a robust volumetric framework to support surgical planning, radiation oncology, and quantitative neuro-oncology diagnostics.

CRediT authorship contribution statement

Shayan Ganji Nataj: Conceptualization, Methodology, Software, Formal analysis, Investigation, Data curation, Visualization, Writing – original draft. **Keivan Borna:** Supervision, Project administration, Writing – review and editing, Validation.

Declaration of Competing Interest

The authors declare that they have no known competing financial interests or personal relationships that could have appeared to influence the work reported in this paper.

Funding

This research did not receive any specific grant from funding agencies in the public, commercial, or not-for-profit sectors.

Data and Code Availability

The TCGA-LGG MRI dataset is publicly available on The Cancer Imaging Archive (TCIA) and Kaggle at: https://www.kaggle.com/datasets/mateuszbuda/lgg-mri-segmentation. The complete codebase, precomputed in-memory cache, and trained fold checkpoints are available at: https://github.com/Shayan-Ganji/lgg_segmentation.

Declaration of generative AI and AI-assisted technologies in the manuscript preparation process

During the preparation of this work, the authors used AI-assisted tools solely for language editing, grammatical polishing, and code debugging assistance. All experimental designs, mathematical formulations, statistical audits, and scientific interpretations were conducted by the authors. After using these tools, the authors reviewed and edited the content as needed and take full responsibility for the content of the published article.

References

[1] D. N. Louis, A. Perry, P. Wesseling, D. J. Brat, I. A. Cree, D. Figarella-Branger, C. Hawkins, H.-K. Ng, S. M. Pfister, G. Reifenberger, et al., The 2021 WHO classification of tumors of the central nervous system: a summary, Neuro-Oncology 23 (8) (2021) 1231–1251. doi:10.1093/neuonc/noab106.

[2] M. Ceccarelli, F. P. Barthel, T. M. Malta, T. S. Sabedot, S. R. Salama, B. A. Murray, O. Morozova, Y. Newton, A. Radenbaugh, S. M. Pagnotta, et al., Molecular profiling reveals biologically discrete subsets and pathways of progression in diffuse glioma, Cell 164 (3) (2016) 550–563. doi:10.1016/j.cell.2015.12.028.

[3] M. Buda, A. Saha, M. A. Mazurowski, Association of genomic subtypes of lower-grade gliomas with shape features automatically extracted by a deep learning algorithm, Computers in Biology and Medicine 109 (2019) 418–425. doi:10.1016/j.compbiomed.2019.04.018.

[4] O. Ronneberger, P. Fischer, T. Brox, U-Net: Convolutional networks for biomedical image segmentation, in: Medical Image Computing and Computer-Assisted Intervention (MICCAI), Springer, 2015, pp. 234–241. doi:10.1007/978-3-319-24574-4_28.

[5] Z. Zhang, Q. Liu, Y. Wang, Road extraction by deep residual U-Net, IEEE Geoscience and Remote Sensing Letters 15 (5) (2018) 749–753. doi:10.1109/LGRS.2018.2802944.

[6] O. Oktay, J. Schlemper, L. L. Folgoc, M. Lee, M. Heinrich, K. Misawa, K. Mori, S. McDonagh, N. Y. Hammerla, B. Kainz, B. Glocker, D. Rueckert, Attention U-Net: Learning where to look for the pancreas, in: Medical Imaging with Deep Learning (MIDL), 2018. doi:10.48550/arXiv.1804.03999.

[7] S. G. Chang, B. Yu, M. Vetterli, Adaptive wavelet thresholding for image denoising and compression, IEEE Transactions on Image Processing 9 (9) (2000) 1532–1546. doi:10.1109/83.862633.

[8] Y. Wu, K. He, Group normalization, in: European Conference on Computer Vision (ECCV), 2018, pp. 3–19. doi:10.1007/978-3-030-01261-8_1.

[9] D. Hendrycks, K. Gimpel, Gaussian error linear units (GELUs), arXiv preprint arXiv:1606.08415doi:10.48550/arXiv.1606.08415.

[10] G. Huang, Y. Sun, Z. Liu, D. Sedra, K. Q. Weinberger, Deep networks with stochastic depth, in: European Conference on Computer Vision (ECCV), 2016, pp. 646–661. doi:10.1007/978-3-319-46493-0_39.

[11] N. Abraham, N. M. Khan, A novel focal Tversky loss function with improved attention U-Net for lesion segmentation, in: IEEE International Symposium on Biomedical Imaging (ISBI), IEEE, 2019, pp. 683–687. doi:10.1109/ISBI.2019.8759450.

[12] T.-Y. Lin, P. Goyal, R. Girshick, K. He, P. Dollár, Focal loss for dense object detection, in: IEEE International Conference on Computer Vision (ICCV), 2017, pp. 2980–2988. doi:10.1109/ICCV.2017.324.

[13] I. Loshchilov, F. Hutter, Decoupled weight decay regularization, in: International Conference on Learning Representations (ICLR), 2019. doi:10.48550/arXiv.1711.05101.

[14] C. Guo, G. Pleiss, Y. Sun, K. Q. Weinberger, On calibration of modern neural networks, in: International Conference on Machine Learning (ICML), PMLR, 2017, pp. 1321–1330. doi:10.48550/arXiv.1706.04599.

[15] P. E. Shrout, J. L. Fleiss, Intraclass correlations: uses in assessing rater reliability, Psychological Bulletin 86 (2) (1979) 420–428. doi:10.1037/0033-2909.86.2.420.

[16] W. Yuan, H. Kang, Enhanced local feature extraction of lite network with scale-invariant CNN for precise segmentation of small brain tumors in MRI, PLOS ONE 20 (1) (2025) e0334447. doi:10.1371/journal.pone.0334447.

[17] S. Alhatamleh, et al., Attention-enhanced SAM with PBFO tuning: advancing glioma MRI segmentation, Frontiers in Medicine 13 (2026) 1730353. doi:10.3389/fmed.2026.1730353.